

Monads in Practice

Lecture 13

Section 1

Part I: Recall — What Is a Monad?

The Monad type class in Lean

You already use monads in Lean. The full interface comes from three classes:

```
class Pure (m : Type -> Type) where
  pure : a -> m a
```

```
class Bind (m : Type -> Type) where
  bind : m a -> (a -> m b) -> m b
```

```
class Monad (m : Type -> Type) extends Applicative m, Bind m
```

- `m` is a type constructor (`Option`, `List`, `StateM s`, `IO`)
- `Pure` provides `pure` — lifts a value into the monad
- `Bind` provides `bind` (also written `>>=`) — chains computations
- `Monad` combines them and provides default implementations

An **instance** supplies `pure` and `bind` for a specific type constructor.

The same class in Haskell

In Haskell, the same concept uses slightly different syntax:

```
class Functor m => Monad m where
  return :: a -> m a
  (>>=)  :: m a -> (a -> m b) -> m b
```

Lean	Haskell
pure	return
bind / >>=	>>=
instance : Monad Option	instance Monad Maybe
do notation	do notation (identical)

We show both syntaxes throughout. The concepts are identical; only the notation differs.

Type classes are not part of $F\omega$

Recall: System $F\omega$ gives us the kind system to *state* that m has kind $* \rightarrow *$. But $F\omega$ alone cannot express “and m must come equipped with `pure` and `bind`.”

A type class is an orthogonal mechanism layered on top. It is a **structure** (a record type) whose fields are functions:

```
structure Monad (m : Type -> Type) where
  pure : a -> m a
  bind  : m a -> (a -> m b) -> m b
```

An **instance** is a *term* of this structure — a concrete record inhabiting those fields. In Lean, classes literally *are* structures, and instances *are* terms.

The compiler passes the record implicitly wherever a `[Monad m]` constraint appears. In raw $F\omega$, you would pass `pure` and `bind` as explicit function arguments.

You already use monads in Lean

Every time you write `by` in a proof, you enter the `TacticM` monad:

- `TacticM` carries the proof state (goals, hypotheses, metavariables)
- Each tactic is a function that transforms this state
- `bind` chains tactics: run the first, feed its updated state to the second
- `do` notation lets you write tactic sequences imperatively

Similarly, every IO program you write in Lean is monadic. What we are doing today is understanding *how the mechanism works* and how to build your own instances.

The composition problem: why we need bind

In a pure world, composing $f : A \rightarrow B$ and $g : B \rightarrow C$ is trivial:

$$g \circ f : A \rightarrow C \quad (g \circ f)(x) = g(f(x))$$

The composition problem: why we need bind

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$$g \circ f : A \rightarrow C \quad (g \circ f)(x) = g(f(x))$$

Now suppose both functions have effects. Their types become $f : A \rightarrow T(B)$ and $g : B \rightarrow T(C)$, where T is the monad.

The problem: f produces a $T(B)$, but g expects a plain B . We cannot compose them directly.

$$A \xrightarrow{f} T(B) \overset{?}{\dashrightarrow} B \xrightarrow{g} T(C)$$

`bind` is the glue: it extracts the value from $T(B)$ (handling whatever effect T represents) and feeds it to g .

Bind is the glue

$$\text{bind} : T(A) \rightarrow (A \rightarrow T(B)) \rightarrow T(B)$$

Given $f : A \rightarrow T(B)$ and $g : B \rightarrow T(C)$, we compose them as:

$$\text{bind } (f \ a) \ g : T(C)$$

This is *not* the same as unwrapping T and discarding the effect. Bind **combines** the effects:

Monad	What bind does with the effect
Option	if f fails, skip g entirely
List	apply g to every result of f , collect all
StateM s	thread the updated state from f into g
IO	sequence the side effects of f before those of g

The monad laws

Not every definition of `pure` and `bind` makes a valid monad. The instance must satisfy three laws:

$$\text{pure } a \gg= f = f \ a \quad \text{(left unit)}$$

$$m \gg= \text{pure} = m \quad \text{(right unit)}$$

$$(m \gg= f) \gg= g = m \gg= (\lambda x. f \ x \gg= g) \quad \text{(associativity)}$$

In words: `pure` does nothing when bound (left and right), and chains of binds can be regrouped freely.

Where the laws come from

Recall from last lecture: effectful programs $A \rightarrow T(B)$ form a category (the **Kleisli category**) with pure as identity and bind as composition. The monad laws are exactly the **category laws**:

Monad law	Category law
left unit	$\text{id} \circ f = f$
right unit	$f \circ \text{id} = f$
associativity	$(h \circ g) \circ f = h \circ (g \circ f)$

If the laws fail, composition of effectful programs is not well-behaved: regrouping a chain of operations could change its meaning.

The laws are your responsibility

Important: neither the Lean nor the Haskell compiler checks the monad laws. The type class mechanism only checks that you provide `pure` and `bind` with the right *types*.

In Lean, you *can* state and prove the laws via `LawfulMonad`:

```
class LawfulMonad (m : Type -> Type) [Monad m]
  extends LawfulApplicative m where
  pure_bind   : forall (x : a) (f : a -> m b),
                pure x >=> f = f x
  bind_assoc  : forall (x : m a) (f : a -> m b) (g : b -> m c),
                x >=> f >=> g = x >=> fun a => f a >=> g
```

But this is a *separate* class you opt into. In Haskell there is no such mechanism — the programmer is simply trusted.

Section 2

Part II: The Option / Maybe Monad

Option: the type

You know this type well. In Lean it is `Option`; in Haskell, `Maybe`.

Lean:

```
inductive Option (a : Type) where
  | none : Option a
  | some : a -> Option a
```

Haskell:

```
data Maybe a = Nothing | Just a
```

As a monad, `Option`/`Maybe` models **computations that can fail**: the effect is “might not produce a result.”

The Option instance (Lean)

```
instance : Monad Option where
  pure x := some x
  bind
    | none, _ => none
    | some x, f => f x
```

- `pure x = some x` — a pure value succeeds trivially
- `bind none _ = none` — first computation failed? Skip the second
- `bind (some x) f = f x` — succeeded? Feed the value to `f`

The Maybe instance (Haskell)

The same instance in Haskell syntax:

```
instance Monad Maybe where
  return x      = Just x
  Nothing >>= f = Nothing
  Just x  >>= f = f x
```

This is the entire implementation. Two lines of pattern matching define how failure propagates through an arbitrarily long chain of computations.

The Lean and Haskell instances are line-for-line the same logic; only the names differ (some/Just, none/Nothing).

Option in action

Suppose we have lookup functions that can fail:

Lean:

```
def lookupStudent : String -> Option Student := ...  
def lookupCourse  : Student -> Option Course  := ...  
def lookupGrade   : Course  -> Option Nat     := ...
```

Haskell:

```
lookupStudent :: String -> Maybe Student  
lookupCourse  :: Student -> Maybe Course  
lookupGrade   :: Course  -> Maybe Int
```

Each can fail. Without monads, you must check each case manually.

Option: chaining with bind

Using `>>=` to chain them — **Lean:**

```
def getGrade (name : String) : Option Nat :=  
  lookupStudent name >>= fun s =>  
    lookupCourse s      >>= fun c =>  
      lookupGrade c
```

Haskell:

```
getGrade name =  
  lookupStudent name >>= \s ->  
    lookupCourse s    >>= \c ->  
      lookupGrade c
```

If any lookup returns `none/Nothing`, the rest is skipped automatically.

Option: tracing the execution

Trace for name = "Alice" (enrolled, grade 85):

`lookupStudent "Alice" ⇒ some alice`

`some alice >>= lookupCourse ⇒ some cs101`

`some cs101 >>= lookupGrade ⇒ some 85`

Now if `lookupStudent "Bob"` returns `none`:

`none >>= lookupCourse ⇒ none`

`none >>= lookupGrade ⇒ none`

Failure propagates automatically. No boilerplate error checking.

Option: do-notation

Both languages have do-notation as syntactic sugar for bind:

Lean:

```
def getGrade (name : String) : Option Nat := do
  let student <- lookupStudent name
  let course  <- lookupCourse student
  lookupGrade course
```

Haskell:

```
getGrade name = do
  student <- lookupStudent name
  course  <- lookupCourse student
  lookupGrade course
```

Read `let x <- m` as: “run `m`; if it succeeds, call the result `x`.”

Section 3

Part III: The List Monad

Lists as nondeterministic computations

The type `List a / [a]` can model **nondeterminism**: a computation that may return zero, one, or many results.

`Option / Maybe` at most one outcome

`List / []` any number of outcomes (including zero)

The List instance

Lean 4 provides Pure and Bind for List but not a full Monad instance.
We provide one:

Lean:

```
instance : Monad List where
  pure x := [x]
  bind xs f := xs.flatMap f
```

Haskell:

```
instance Monad [] where
  return x = [x]
  xs >>= f = concatMap f xs
```

Apply f to every element, each producing a list, then flatten. If $xs = [x_1, x_2, x_3]$:

$$[x_1, x_2, x_3] \gg= f = f\ x_1 ++ f\ x_2 ++ f\ x_3$$

List: a worked example

Compute all pairs by picking one element from each of two lists:

Lean:

```
def pairs : List (Nat * Char) := do
  let x <- [1, 2, 3]
  let y <- ['a', 'b']
  pure (x, y)
```

Haskell:

```
pairs = do
  x <- [1, 2, 3]
  y <- ['a', 'b']
  return (x, y)
```

The do-notation is nearly identical in both languages.

List: tracing the example

For `x = 1`: `['a','b'].flatMap (fun y => [(1,y)])` gives
`[(1,'a'), (1,'b')]`

For `x = 2`: `[(2,'a'), (2,'b')]`

For `x = 3`: `[(3,'a'), (3,'b')]`

Concatenated:

`[(1,'a'), (1,'b'), (2,'a'), (2,'b'), (3,'a'), (3,'b')]`

Each `let x <- [1,2,3]` branches into three paths; each `let y <- ['a','b']` branches again. The list monad explores the full Cartesian product.

List: Pythagorean triples (Haskell)

A classic example — find all Pythagorean triples up to n :

```
triples n = do
  a <- [1..n]; b <- [a..n]; c <- [b..n]
  if a*a + b*b == c*c then return (a,b,c) else []
```

triples 20 gives

```
[(3,4,5),(5,12,13),(6,8,10),(8,15,17),(9,12,15)]
```

Returning `[]` prunes a branch; `return x` keeps it.

List: Pythagorean triples (Lean)

The same program in Lean:

```
def triples (n : Nat) : List (Nat * Nat * Nat) := do
  let a <- List.range' 1 n
  let b <- List.range' a (n + 1 - a)
  let c <- List.range' b (n + 1 - b)
  if a*a + b*b == c*c then pure (a, b, c) else []
```

List.range' start count gives [start, ..., start+count-1].

The logic is line-for-line the same: do-notation, monadic binding with `let x <- xs`, and `[]` to prune branches. Only the range syntax differs.

Comparing Option and List

	Option / Maybe	List / []
pure x	some x / Just x	[x]
>>= on fail/empty	short-circuit	produce []
>>= on success	apply f to the value	apply f to all, flatten
Effect	partiality	nondeterminism

The do-notation code looks identical in both; only the instance determines the behavior.

Section 4

Part IV: The State Monad

Recall: stateful computations as functions

A computation that reads and writes state of type s , producing a result of type a , is a function $s \rightarrow (a, s)$. In Lean this is `StateM s a`; in Haskell, `State s a`.

Lean:

```
def StateT (s : Type) (m : Type -> Type) (a : Type) :=  
  s -> m (a * s)
```

```
abbrev StateM (s : Type) := StateT s Id  
-- so StateM s a = s -> a * s
```

Haskell:

```
newtype State s a = State { runState :: s -> (a, s) }
```

A value of type `StateM Nat String` is a function $\text{Nat} \rightarrow \text{String} \times \text{Nat}$ waiting to be called. It has not run yet.

The State instance

Lean (simplified):

```
instance : Monad (StateM s) where
  pure a := fun s => (a, s)
  bind m f := fun s => let (a, s') := m s; f a s'
```

Haskell:

```
instance Monad (State s) where
  return a = State (\s -> (a, s))
  m >>= f  = State (\s ->
    let (a, s') = runState m s in runState (f a) s')
```

pure a: leave state unchanged, produce a. ; bind m f: run m on s, get (a, s'), then run f a on s'.

State: the primitive operations

We need ways to **read** and **write** the state. **Lean:**

```
def get : StateM s s := fun s => (s, s)
def set (s' : s) : StateM s Unit := fun _ => ((), s')
def modify (f : s -> s) : StateM s Unit := fun s => ((), f s)
```

Haskell:

```
get      = State (\s -> (s, s))
put s'   = State (\_ -> ((), s'))
modify f = State (\s -> ((), f s))
```


State: a counter example

Lean:

```
def incr : StateM Nat Unit := modify fun x => x + 1
def threeIncrements : StateM Nat Unit := do incr; incr; incr
#eval threeIncrements.run 0      -- ((), 3)
```

Haskell:

```
incr = modify (+1)
threeIncrements = do incr; incr; incr
runState threeIncrements 0      -- ((), 3)
```

Note: `threeIncrements` is a pure function. No mutation has occurred; we described a computation and then ran it.

State: Fibonacci

Imperative-style Fibonacci. **Lean:**

```
def fib (n : Nat) : Nat :=  
  let loop : StateM (Nat * Nat) Nat := do  
    for _ in [:n] do  
      let (a, b) <- get; set (b, a + b)  
      let (a, _) <- get; pure a  
  (loop.run (0, 1)).1
```

Haskell:

```
fib n = fst $ runState loop (0, 1) where  
  loop = do forM_ [1..n] $ \_ -> do  
    (a, b) <- get; put (b, a + b)  
    (a, _) <- get; return a
```

Trace for fib 5: $(0,1) \rightarrow (1,1) \rightarrow (1,2) \rightarrow (2,3) \rightarrow (3,5) \rightarrow (5,8)$.
Result: 5 ; (✓).

State: tracing the bind

Let us trace `bind get (fun s => set (s+1))` with initial state 5:

```
bind m f = fun s =>
```

```
  let (a, s') := m s           -- get 5 = (5, 5)
```

```
  f a s'                       ;; -- set 6 5 = ((), 6)
```

Result: `((), 6)`

The state 5 was read, incremented to 6, and stored — all via pure function composition. No mutation occurred.

Section 5

Part V: The IO Monad

IO: the opaque monad

IO α represents a computation that interacts with the outside world. Both languages have it.

Lean:

```
IO.println  : String -> IO Unit  
IO.FS.readFile : System.FilePath -> IO String
```

Haskell:

```
putStrLn :: String -> IO ()  
readFile :: FilePath -> IO String
```

Unlike Option and List, you **cannot pattern match** on an IO value. IO is abstract by design. The only way to combine IO actions is through pure and bind.

IO: a simple program

Lean:

```
def main : IO Unit := do
  IO.println "What is your name?"
  let stdin <- IO.getStdin
  let name <- stdin.getLine
  IO.println s!"Hello, {name}!"
```

Haskell:

```
main :: IO ()
main = do
  putStrLn "What is your name?"
  name <- getLine
  putStrLn ("Hello, " ++ name ++ "!")
```

Each line in the do-block desugars to a bind. The syntax is nearly identical.

Pure monads vs. IO

`Option`, `List`, and `StateM` are **pure**: they simulate effects by composing ordinary functions. You can run them yourself.

IO is different. The state is the entire real world. Only the runtime executes IO actions, by running `main`.

	Pure monads	IO
State	a value you provide	the real world
Run it yourself?	yes (<code>.run</code> , etc.)	no (only <code>main</code>)
Deterministic?	same input $\Rightarrow$ same output	no

Section 6

Part VI: Putting It All Together

The pattern

Every monad instance follows the same structure:

- 1 Pick a type constructor $T : \text{Type} \rightarrow \text{Type}$
- 2 Define `pure : a -> T a` (embed a pure value)
- 3 Define `bind : T a -> (a -> T b) -> T b` (compose)
- 4 Verify the three monad laws (optionally prove via `LawfulMonad`)

Once you have an instance, **all generic monad machinery works**:
`do`-notation, `List.mapM`, `forM`, `sequence`, ...

You write these combinators *once*, and they work for every monad.

Summary of instances

Lean	Haskell	<code>pure a</code>	<code>bind</code>	Effect
<code>Option</code>	<code>Maybe</code>	<code>some a</code>	<code>skip/apply</code>	failure
<code>List</code>	<code>[]</code>	<code>[a]</code>	<code>flatMap</code>	nondet.
<code>StateM s</code>	<code>State s</code>	<code>λs.(a,s)</code>	<code>thread state</code>	mut. state
<code>IO</code>	<code>IO</code>	<code>yield a</code>	<code>sequence</code>	real world

Four computational patterns, one uniform interface. The `do`-block structure works regardless of which monad you are in.

Generic code: an example

```
def mapM' [Monad m] (f : a -> m b) : List a -> m Unit
| []      => pure ()
| x :: xs => f x >>= fun _ => mapM' f xs
```

This works for *any* monad. Instantiate:

- `m = IO`: performs an IO action on each element
- `m = Option`: applies a failable operation; short-circuits on failure
- `m = StateM s`: applies a stateful operation, threading state
- `m = List`: nondeterministic operation, collecting all outcomes

You wrote `mapM'` once. The instance determines the behavior.

Section 7

Summary

What we covered

- 1 **Recall**: the `Monad` class in Lean (and Haskell); monads in Lean's tactic mode
- 2 **Bind as glue**: composing effectful programs $A \rightarrow T(B)$ and $B \rightarrow T(C)$
- 3 **Option / Maybe**: the instance, failure propagation, do-notation
- 4 **List**: the instance, nondeterminism, Pythagorean triples
- 5 **StateM / State**: the instance, get/set, Fibonacci
- 6 **IO**: the opaque monad, sequencing, pure vs. IO

Next lecture: type inference.

System F's type inference is undecidable (Wells, 1999). The fix is the **Hindley–Milner** type system: restrict to prenex polymorphism, allow generalization only at `let`-bindings, and use **unification** as the engine.

This is what makes all of the Haskell code we wrote today work without explicit type annotations. Lean uses a more powerful elaboration algorithm, but the core idea — unification — is the same.